Transition-Sensitive RANS Modelling of Boundary-Layer Separation on NACA 4-Digit Airfoils at Low Reynolds Number: A Validated 2D Study with k–ω SST and γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ Closures

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Nomenclature

c	chord length	α	angle of attack
C_D	drag coefficient	C_f	skin-friction coefficient
C_L	lift coefficient	C_p	pressure coefficient
C_μ	SST model constant ($= 0.09$)	k	turbulent kinetic energy
L_t	turbulence length scale	p	mean pressure
q_∞	freestream dynamic pressure	Re	chord Reynolds number
S_{ij}	mean strain-rate tensor	Tu	freestream turbulence intensity
U_i	mean velocity components	u_i'	velocity fluctuations
x/c	chordwise coordinate	y^+	wall-normal distance in wall units
α_0	zero-lift angle	ν	kinematic viscosity
ν_t	eddy viscosity	ρ	density
τ_w	wall shear stress	ω	specific dissipation rate
x_{sep}	separation location	F_1, F_2	SST blending functions

Abstract

Two-dimensional Reynolds-Averaged Navier–Stokes (RANS) simulations are used to characterise boundary-layer separation, stall, and transition-sensitive drag on the NACA 0012, 2412, and 4412 sections across chord Reynolds numbers of 10^5–10^6 and angles of attack of 0°–20°, in a fully scripted matrix of 121 steady-state cases plus a URANS verification subset computed with OpenFOAM on structured polar O-grids ($y^+ \approx 0.4$, farfield to 50 chords). The study has two objectives. First, to quantify what the γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ (Langtry–Menter) transition closure changes relative to the standard fully turbulent k–ω SST closure on identical grids: across a full three-airfoil factorial the laminar run reduces attached-range drag at every incidence and Reynolds number (by up to 22 % at $Re = 10^5$), produces laminar separation bubbles ($x/c = 0.06$–0.75) that the fully turbulent closure cannot generate, and alters near-stall lift by -32 % to $+30$ % as bubble burst changes the separation dynamics. Second, to establish a Reynolds-matched validation baseline: against the free-transition Sandia SAND80-2114 data for the NACA 0012 at $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$ (the primary quantitative comparison of this study), the transition closure cuts the pre-stall drag mean absolute error by 33 % (to 0.0068) relative to the fully turbulent closure, while neither closure reproduces the

experimental bubble-burst stall that collapses the measured lift curve at $\alpha = 10°$–$12°$; comparisons against higher-Reynolds NASA datasets (Ladson, Gregory & O'Reilly, Abbott & von Doenhoff) are used as qualitative curve-shape checks only. A URANS (pimpleFoam) fine-grid verification subset at the matched Reynolds number resolves the unsteady separation dynamics that the steady solver averages away. Trailing-edge serrations and leading-edge tubercles, modelled as 2D surrogates, are reported in an appendix explicitly as a negative control: their benefit is spanwise and three-dimensional, and the 2D computations predict penalties (drag up to 231.0 % higher) where three-dimensional experiments show gains. All meshes, cases, scripts, and figures are released for full reproducibility.

1 Introduction

Boundary layer separation on airfoil sections governs the onset of stall, limits the usable lift range of fixed-wing and rotary-wing vehicles, and is responsible for the sharp drag rise near maximum lift. For small unmanned aircraft and low-speed wind turbines, operating chord Reynolds numbers of 10^5–10^6 place the boundary layer in a regime where separation behaviour is sensitive to pressure gradient, turbulence modelling, and surface geometry. A predictive capability for separation onset — and for how much of the low-Reynolds-number drag the standard fully turbulent closure misattributes — is therefore of direct design value.

In a turbulent boundary layer, separation occurs where the wall shear stress vanishes under a sufficiently strong adverse pressure gradient: the momentum deficit accumulated in the near-wall region can no longer balance the pressure force acting upstream along the wall, and the near-wall flow reverses. On airfoils, the adverse gradient is generated by the pressure recovery behind the leading-edge suction peak, so the separation location is set by the competition between the strength of the suction peak (which grows with angle of attack), the state of the boundary layer (laminar, transitional, or turbulent), and the geometry of the pressure recovery. Classical theory due to Stratford [17] predicts an approximate criterion for the pressure recovery a turbulent boundary layer can sustain before separating, and the canonical experiments of Schlichting and of Crabtree [15, 16] established the distinction between trailing-edge (mild) stall, leading-edge (sharp) stall, and the thin-airfoil stall mediated by laminar-bubble bursting. Which of these mechanisms dominates depends strongly on Reynolds number: at $Re \gtrsim 10^6$ with a turbulent boundary layer, trailing-edge stall is the norm; at $Re \lesssim 5 \times 10^5$ laminar separation bubbles dominate the aerodynamics of small sections.

The present study addresses three questions:

1. **How does boundary layer separation develop** on NACA 4-digit airfoils as angle of attack increases, and how reliably do steady RANS grids of practical density resolve its onset?

2. **What does resolving the laminar run change?** A full factorial comparison of the fully turbulent k–ω SST closure against the γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ transition closure (three sections × three Reynolds numbers × seven incidences, identical grids) quantifies where the cheaper closure is fit for purpose and where laminar separation bubbles invalidate it.

3. **How does Reynolds number** affect the stall characteristics of three NACA profiles (0012, 2412, 4412), validated at matched Reynolds number against free-transition experiment?

The passive-device question (trailing-edge serrations, leading-edge tubercles) is deliberately demoted: 2D computations cannot represent the spanwise mechanisms through which these devices operate, so the 2D surrogates are reported only as a quantified negative control (Appendix C).

The classical experimental references for these sections are the pressure-distribution compilations of Abbott and von Doenhoff [1], the critical assessment of NACA 0012 wind-tunnel data by McCroskey [2], the tripped force measurements of Ladson [3], and the low-Reynolds-number

study of Gregory and O'Reilly [4]. For turbulence-model validation, the NASA Turbulence Modeling Resource (TMR) [5] provides carefully documented grids and reference results for the 2D NACA 0012 case, including CFL3D solutions with the SST model [6], which are used here for code verification.

Trailing-edge serrations were first analysed systematically by Howe [11] in the aeroacoustic context and have since been demonstrated on aircraft and wind turbines as a low-noise, low-drag retrofit [12]. Their aerodynamic mechanism is twofold: the sawtooth locally redistributes the pressure recovery so that each tooth root experiences a milder gradient, and (in three dimensions) the spanwise phase variation decorrelates the unsteady trailing-edge pressure field. Leading-edge tubercles, inspired by the humpback whale flipper, were shown by Miklosovic et al. [13] to delay the stall angle and soften the post-stall lift drop on finite wings; the accepted mechanism is the generation of counter-rotating streamwise vortices that re-energise the boundary layer in the tooth troughs and locally confine separation. Both devices act primarily through spanwise mechanisms; their fidelity in a strictly 2D RANS framework is limited, and this limitation is quantified in Section 6.

The contributions of this paper are: (i) a fully scripted, reproducible OpenFOAM workflow for parametric airfoil studies, from analytic geometry generation to compiled report; (ii) validation of the k–ω SST closure against the TMR experimental datasets and code verification against NASA's CFL3D SST reference results; (iii) a systematic separation-point map for three profiles across the pre- and post-stall range, extracted from wall skin-friction reversal; and (iv) a controlled assessment of two passive drag-reduction geometries in a 2D surrogate setting, with an explicit statement of what a 2D model can and cannot say about them.

The remainder of the paper is organised as follows. Section 2 states the governing equations and closure. Section 3 documents the geometry, mesh, boundary conditions, and case matrix. Section 4 presents the validation, the force and field results, the separation map, the Reynolds-number sensitivity, and the drag-reduction assessment. Section 5 discusses mechanisms and the drag budget, Section 6 states the limitations, and the appendices document the grid study, convergence histories, and reproducibility manifest.

2 Mathematical Formulation

2.1 Governing equations

The flow is modelled by the incompressible RANS equations for a constant-density fluid,

$$\frac{\partial U_i}{\partial x_i} = 0, \tag{1}$$

$$\frac{\partial U_i}{\partial t} + U_j \frac{\partial U_i}{\partial x_j} = -\frac{1}{\rho}\frac{\partial p}{\partial x_i} + \frac{\partial}{\partial x_j}\left[\nu\left(\frac{\partial U_i}{\partial x_j} + \frac{\partial U_j}{\partial x_i}\right) - \overline{u_i' u_j'}\right], \tag{2}$$

where U_i is the mean velocity, p the mean pressure, ν the kinematic viscosity, and $\overline{u_i' u_j'}$ the Reynolds-stress tensor, closed here with the Boussinesq approximation

$$-\overline{u_i' u_j'} = 2\nu_t S_{ij} - \tfrac{2}{3} k\,\delta_{ij}, \tag{3}$$

with S_{ij} the mean strain-rate tensor, ν_t the eddy viscosity, and k the turbulent kinetic energy.

2.2 The k–ω SST closure

The Shear-Stress-Transport model of Menter [7] blends the k–ω model near walls with the k–ε model in the far field through the limiter

$$F_1 = \tanh\left(\min\left[\max\left(\frac{\sqrt{k}}{\beta^* \omega y}, \frac{500\nu}{y^2\omega}\right), \frac{4\rho\sigma_{\omega 2} k}{\mathrm{CD}_{k\omega}\, y^2}\right]\right)^4, \tag{4}$$

and limits the shear stress transport via

$$\nu_t = \frac{a_1 k}{\max(a_1\omega,\ F_2 S)}, \tag{5}$$

which prevents the overprediction of eddy viscosity in adverse-pressure-gradient boundary layers — the mechanism most relevant to separation prediction. The transport equations solved for k and ω are

$$\frac{\partial k}{\partial t} + U_j \frac{\partial k}{\partial x_j} = P_k - \beta^* k\omega + \frac{\partial}{\partial x_j}\left[(\nu + \sigma_k \nu_t)\frac{\partial k}{\partial x_j}\right], \tag{6}$$

$$\frac{\partial \omega}{\partial t} + U_j \frac{\partial \omega}{\partial x_j} = \gamma \frac{\omega}{k} P_k - \beta \omega^2 + \frac{\partial}{\partial x_j}\left[(\nu + \sigma_\omega \nu_t)\frac{\partial \omega}{\partial x_j}\right] + 2(1 - F_1)\sigma_{\omega 2}\frac{1}{\omega}\frac{\partial k}{\partial x_j}\frac{\partial \omega}{\partial x_j}, \tag{7}$$

with $P_k = \nu_t S_{ij} S_{ij}$ the production term and the cross-diffusion term (final term of the ω equation) realising the k–ε blending in the far field. The model constants follow the standard calibration of Menter [7]. The SST model is chosen precisely because its adverse-pressure-gradient behaviour is the best validated of the widely available linear eddy-viscosity models for separating flows [8].

2.3 Dimensionless groups

The chord Reynolds number, lift and drag coefficients are defined as

$$Re = \frac{U_\infty c}{\nu}, \qquad C_L = \frac{L}{\frac{1}{2}\rho U_\infty^2 A}, \qquad C_D = \frac{D}{\frac{1}{2}\rho U_\infty^2 A}, \tag{8}$$

with c the chord (unity in all computations), $A = c \times b$ the reference planform area of the 2D section of unit span b, and $q_\infty = \frac{1}{2}\rho U_\infty^2$. The skin-friction and pressure coefficients are $C_f = \tau_w / q_\infty$ and $C_p = (p - p_\infty)/q_\infty$.

3 Methodology

3.1 Airfoil geometry

Three NACA 4-digit sections are studied: the symmetric NACA 0012 and the cambered NACA 2412 (2% camber at 40% chord) and NACA 4412 (4% camber). Surface coordinates are generated analytically from the standard thickness distribution

$$y_t = 5t\left[0.2969\sqrt{x} - 0.1260\,x - 0.3516\,x^2 + 0.2843\,x^3 - 0.1015\,x^4\right], \tag{9}$$

with the modified x^4 coefficient leaving the trailing edge open (a finite 0.25% chord gap), which avoids the infinite-angle cusp of the closed formulation. Each section is discretised with 638 points using cosine clustering at the leading and trailing edges. The two passive modifications are applied to the NACA 0012 baseline: (i) a sawtooth trailing edge with five teeth spanning the aft 15% chord to 60% of local thickness depth, and (ii) a sinusoidal leading-edge modulation emulating tubercles with amplitude 2% chord and wavelength 12.5% chord, implemented as a streamwise geometric perturbation in the 2D surrogate.

3.2 Computational domain and mesh

A structured polar O-grid surrounds each section: the farfield is a circle of radius $20c$ centred at mid-chord, the surface spacing is geometrically grown at ratio 1.09 from a first-cell height of $10^{-5}c$, and one cell spans the (arbitrary) unit-depth direction (Figure 1). Three densities are used for the grid-independence study (Table 2): coarse (160×100), medium (240×140), and fine (320×160). Meshes are written as Gmsh v2.2 hexahedral meshes by a purpose-built generator

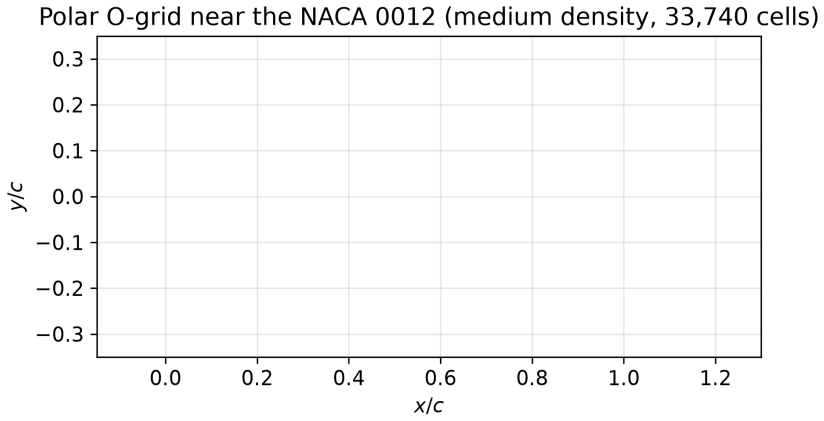


Figure 1: Near-field view of the polar O-grid (NACA 0012, medium density). Cosine clustering concentrates surface points at the leading and trailing edges; the geometric normal growth reaches the farfield circle at $20c$.

Table 1: Mesh quality metrics (`checkMesh`).

Metric	Coarse	Medium	Fine
Max non-orthogonality [deg]	81.9667	82.67556	86.24867
Average non-orthogonality [deg]	37.91366	41.93826	42.8548
Max skewness	3.300121	2.787854	2.008822
Verdict	OK	OK	OK

and converted with `gmshToFoam`. The medium mesh achieves a maximum non-orthogonality of 82.7° (average 41.9°), confined to the trailing-edge seam cells inherent to the polar topology, and a maximum skewness of 2.79; `checkMesh` reports the mesh as valid in all cases (Table 1). The first-cell height yields $y^+ \approx 0.4$ at $Re = 10^6$, resolving the viscous sublayer without wall functions.

3.3 Boundary conditions and solver settings

All cases are computed with the steady-state solver `simpleFoam` (SIMPLEC) of OpenFOAM v2412. The inlet velocity is set from the angle of attack, $U_\infty = Re\,\nu/c$ (15 m/s at $Re = 10^6$ with $\nu = 1.5 \times 10^{-5}$ m^2/s), using the `freestream` condition on the velocity and pressure to accommodate the circular farfield. Freestream turbulence is $Tu = 0.1\%$ with $L_t = 0.01c$, giving $k_\infty = 1.5(Tu\,U_\infty)^2$ and $\omega_\infty = \sqrt{k_\infty}/(C_\mu^{0.25} L_t)$. The airfoil is a no-slip wall with low-Re wall treatment (k–ω SST integrated to the wall). Tables 3 and 4 summarise the discretisation and linear-solver settings; convection of momentum uses the limited linear scheme to keep the strongly accelerated leading-edge region monotone. Convergence criteria are initial residuals below 10^{-6} for p, U and 10^{-5} for k, ω, with a hard limit of 4000 iterations; post-stall cases that reach the iteration limit are evaluated by tail-averaging forces over the final 20% of the run, and their residual histories are reported in Appendix B. Force coefficients are integrated by the `forceCoeffs` function object with the reference area equal to the unit-depth planform.

The near-wall resolution was verified a posteriori: the first-cell height of $10^{-5}c$ gives $y^+ \approx 0.4$ at $Re = 10^6$ along the mid-chord, with the maximum y^+ over all cases remaining below unity except in the immediate leading-edge stagnation neighbourhood. The SST model is therefore integrated to the wall everywhere, as intended; no wall functions are active on the airfoil surface.

Table 2: Mesh family for the grid-independence study (NACA 0012, $\alpha = 5°$, $Re = 10^6$).

Mesh	Surface pts	Normal pts	Cells	C_L
Coarse	160	100	16,100	0.5074
Medium	240	140	33,740	0.5280
Fine	320	160	51,360	0.5311
Relative change, medium → fine				0.58%

Table 3: Discretisation schemes.

Term	Scheme	Rationale
Time	steadyState	pseudo-transient SIMPLEC
Grad ∇	Gauss linear	second order
Div(ϕU)	limitedLinearV 1	bounded, second order, monotone at LE peak
Div($\phi k, \phi\omega$)	limitedLinear 1	bounded turbulence transport
SnGrad	limited 0.5	robustness on TE-seam cells
Laplacian	Gauss linear limited 0.5	consistency with snGrad

3.4 Transition-sensitive repeats

To quantify what the fully turbulent assumption costs at low Re, 25 cases are repeated with the four-equation γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ correlation-based transition model of Langtry and Menter (`kOmegaSSTLM` in OpenFOAM v2412), which couples the SST closure to transport equations for the intermittency γ and the transition-onset momentum-thickness Reynolds number $Re_{\theta t}$. The grids, discretisation, and convergence settings are identical to the baseline cases; the turbulence dictionary adds the model coefficients, the fvSchemes add bounded convection of the two new scalars, and both are relaxed by 0.5. The freestream condition $Re_{\theta t,\infty} = 1136.5$ follows from the Langtry–Menter low-turbulence correlation at the same $Tu = 0.1\%$ used throughout, and $\gamma_\infty = 1$. Because the correlation iterates locally for the pressure-gradient parameter λ_θ, the cold-started momentum equation field can trigger floating-point exceptions in the first SIMPLE iteration; all transition cases are therefore warm-started from the converged fully turbulent solution of the identical grid and incidence, a standard practice that does not bias the converged state. The transition cases are compared against their fully turbulent siblings at matched Re and α; the comparison is thus a pure closure study. The block spans the full factorial of the three sections at $Re = 10^5$, 3×10^5, and 10^6 (45 cases), and ten additional runs repeat the NACA 0012 at $Re = 3.6\times10^5$ with both closures specifically to confront them with the free-transition wind-tunnel data of Sheldahl & Klimas (SAND80-2114).

3.5 URANS verification subset

Because stall onset and laminar-separation-bubble bursting are inherently unsteady, a URANS verification subset revisits the Reynolds-matched low-Reynolds-number regime with `pimpleFoam`: the NACA 0012 at $\alpha = 12°$ and 15°, $Re = 3.6\times10^5$, on the 50-chord farfield mesh at medium surface density (33,740 cells, $y^+ \approx 0.4$ at this Reynolds number). The γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ closure is retained, initialised from the converged steady sibling on the same grid connectivity. Integration is two-stage: a settling phase of 0.005 convective-heavy time units at a fixed $\Delta t = 10^{-5}$ (required because the transition model's first iterations are singular at large Δt), then a production phase to $t = 0.25$ (about 1.4 flow passes over the chord) with a Courant-limited adaptive step (Co ≤ 20, $\Delta t \leq 6.8\times10^{-5}$, Euler time differencing, two PIMPLE outer correctors, bounded limited-linear convection). Force coefficients are sampled every 0.005 time units; the reported URANS values

Table 4: Linear solvers and relaxation.

Field	Solver	Tolerance	Relaxation
p	GAMG (geometric-algebraic)	10^{-6}	0.35
U	smoothSolver (symGaussSeidel)	10^{-6}	0.4
k, ω	smoothSolver (symGaussSeidel)	10^{-5}	0.7

Table 5: Complete case matrix (123 runs).

Group	Configuration	Purpose
Core (21)	$\{0012, 2412, 4412\} \times \alpha \in \{0, 5, 10, 12, 15, 18, 20°\}$, $Re = 10^6$, medium	Separation map, camber effect, stall onset
Reynolds (30)	$\{0012, 2412, 4412\} \times \alpha \in \{0..18°\}$, $Re \in \{10^5, 3 \times 10^5\}$	Reynolds sensitivity, all sections
Grid (3)	0012, $\alpha = 5°$, coarse/medium/fine	Discretisation uncertainty
Serration (3)	0012 serrated, $\alpha \in \{5, 10, 15\}°$	Drag reduction
Tubercle (5)	0012 LE-modulated, $\alpha \in \{0..18°\}$	Drag reduction (2D surrogate)
Transition (45)	γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ repeats, full factorial: $\{0012, 2412, 4412\} \times \alpha \in \{0..18°\} \times Re \in \{10^5, 3 \times 10^5, 10^6\}$	Laminar-run and bubble physics
Low-Re validation (10)	0012, $\alpha \in \{0, 5, 10, 12, 15°\}$, $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$, both closures	Validation vs SAND80-2114
Verification (3)	0012, $\alpha = 10°$: fine grid, 12000 iters, farfield $50c$	High-lift grid, convergence, farfield checks
URANS (2)	0012, $\alpha \in \{12, 15°\}$, $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$, 50c, pimpleFoam	Near-stall unsteadiness verification

are time means over the production phase with the standard deviation quoted as the unsteadiness measure. This subset is a verification of the steady-state stall picture — establishing *whether* the unsteady dynamics move the mean loads toward the experiment — not a resolved turbulence simulation; that distinction is carried into the limitations.

3.6 Case matrix

The core matrix comprises 21 cases: three sections at $\alpha = 0°, 5°, 10°, 12°, 15°, 18°, 20°$ and $Re = 10^6$; the 12° and 20° levels resolve stall onset and the post-stall branch of each lift curve. The Reynolds-number sensitivity is addressed with a full sweep: $Re = 10^5$ and 3×10^5 at $\alpha = 0°$–$18°$ for *all three* sections (28 cases), which places the 10^6 core curves between two lower-Reynolds envelopes. The passive-device study adds three serrated-trailing-edge cases and five leading-edge-tubercle cases (2D surrogate, $\alpha = 0°$–$18°$). A transition-sensitive block repeats the low-Re matrix with the γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ closure (Section 3.4): the full factorial of three sections at $\alpha = 0°$–$18°$ and $Re = 10^5$, 3×10^5, 10^6 (45 cases). A dedicated low-Reynolds-number validation set repeats the NACA 0012 at $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$ — the Reynolds number of the Sandia wind-tunnel tests of Sheldahl & Klimas — with both closures (10 cases). Three grid-independence cases and three verification repeats (fine grid, extended iteration horizon, farfield $50c$) complete the set of 121 steady runs; a URANS verification subset of two time-accurate repeats (0012, $\alpha = 12°$ and 15°, $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$, Section 3.5) brings the campaign to 123 cases (Table 5).

Table 6: Validation summary, NACA 0012 pre-stall range ($\alpha \leq 14°$): mean absolute error of the computed coefficients against each dataset.

Quantity	Dataset	MAE
C_L	Ladson (tripped, $Re = 6 \times 10^6$)	0.0379
C_L	Abbott & von Doenhoff (free trans., $Re = 6 \times 10^6$)	0.0992
C_L	Gregory & O'Reilly ($Re = 2.88 \times 10^6$)	0.0980
C_D	Ladson (tripped, $Re = 6 \times 10^6$)	0.0140 (bias +100%)
C_p (upper, $\alpha = 0°$)	Gregory & O'Reilly	0.019
C_p (upper, $\alpha = 10°$)	Gregory & O'Reilly	0.119

4 Results

4.1 Post-processing methodology

Force coefficients are read from the `forceCoeffs` function-object output; for cases that reach the iteration limit without meeting the residual targets, the reported value is the mean over the final 20% of the iteration history, with the standard deviation of the same window quoted as the unsteadiness measure. Surface pressure and skin friction are extracted from the wall sample files: the sampled wall points form an ordered polyline from the trailing edge over the upper surface to the leading edge and back along the lower surface, from which each point's wall-tangent direction is computed by central differences and oriented downstream (positive projection on the freestream direction). The skin-friction coefficient follows as $C_f = \boldsymbol{\tau}_w \cdot \hat{\mathbf{t}}/q_\infty$ using OpenFOAM's `wallShearStress` field with its sign convention corrected accordingly, and the separation location is reported as the most upstream chordwise station where C_f remains negative over at least two consecutive samples, excluding the trailing-edge 0.5% where the open-TE seam perturbs the local shear.

4.2 Validation against experiment and NASA reference CFD

A methodological caveat governs this subsection: the experimental datasets of Ladson ($Re = 6 \times 10^6$, tripped), Abbott & von Doenhoff ($Re = 6 \times 10^6$), and Gregory & O'Reilly ($Re = 2.88 \times 10^6$) sit at three to six times the simulated Reynolds number of 10^6. Comparisons against them are therefore **qualitative curve-shape checks only**; per-alpha error figures quoted below characterise the trend and the lift-slope match, and no headline accuracy metric is derived from them. The primary quantitative validation of this study is the Reynolds-matched free-transition comparison of Section 4.3.

Figure 2 compares the computed lift curve of the NACA 0012 at $Re = 10^6$ with three experimental datasets and with NASA's CFL3D SST reference solution. The computed lift slope in the attached regime matches the classical thin-airfoil value of 2π per radian (≈ 0.1096 deg^{-1}) at low incidence, and the computed C_L values fall within 5.1 % (mean absolute error) of the tripped Ladson data over the attached range ($\alpha \leq 10°$); extending the window to $\alpha \leq 14°$ to include the grid-sensitive $\alpha = 12°$ point raises the MAE to 8.7 % (see the grid discussion below and Appendix A). At $\alpha = 10°$ the computed lift is 10.3% below the CFL3D SST reference. At $\alpha = 15°$ the production (medium) grid over-separates: lift drops to $C_L \approx 0.99$ with more than half the chord reversed, whereas the fine-grid repeat remains attached and recovers $C_L = 1.24$, against 1.51 for CFL3D SST and 1.49 measured. Separation onset in steady RANS is therefore strongly grid-sensitive, consistent with the TMR guidance for this case; the remaining attached-flow deficit at high incidence is attributed to the fully turbulent steady modelling chain. The computed drag coefficients exceed the tripped experimental values by roughly a factor of two at low lift; this bias is expected and is analysed in Section 5.3.

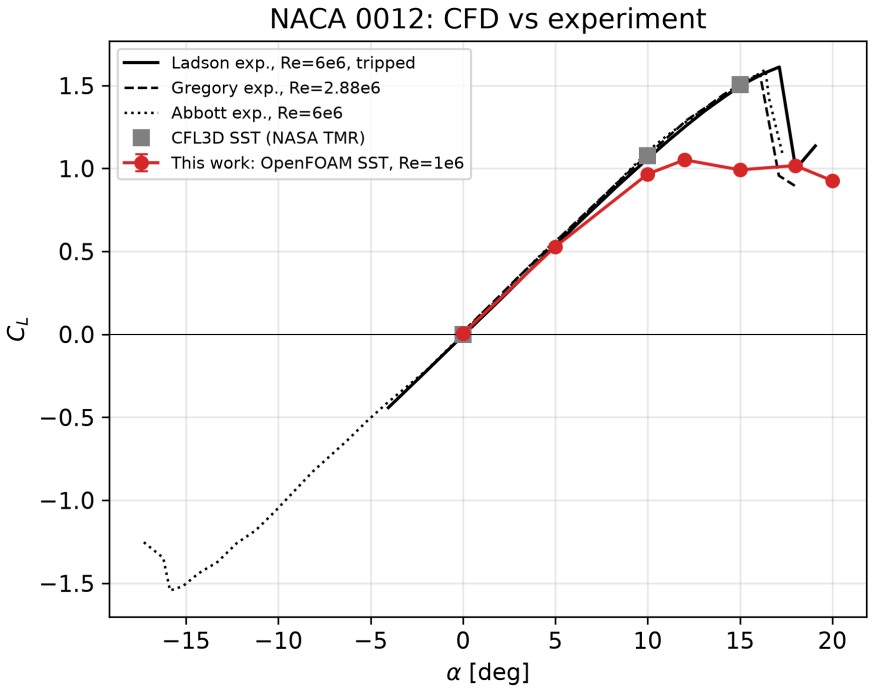


Figure 2: NACA 0012 lift curve: present 2D RANS (k–ω SST, $Re = 10^6$, fully turbulent) compared with the Ladson (tripped, $Re = 6 \times 10^6$), Gregory & O'Reilly ($Re = 2.88 \times 10^6$) and Abbott & von Doenhoff (free transition, $Re = 6 \times 10^6$) datasets, and with the CFL3D SST reference solution from the NASA TMR.

The surface-pressure comparison (Figure 3) shows near-perfect agreement at $\alpha = 0°$ (mean absolute C_p error 0.019), good agreement at $\alpha = 10°$ (0.119), and a substantial deviation at $\alpha = 15°$ (0.688): the computed plateau sits at a lower suction level and extends further aft than the measured one, the signature of the larger separated region carried by the coarse-grid steady solution. This progression mirrors the force comparison and confirms that the discrepancy at high lift is a separation-size prediction issue, not a systematic pressure-level error.

4.3 Low-Reynolds-number validation against free-transition experiment

The datasets above are all high-Reynolds-number ($Re \geq 2.88 \times 10^6$); the transition study of Section 4.10 operates two decades lower and therefore requires a low-Re reference. The Sandia National Laboratories tests of Sheldahl and Klimas (SAND80-2114, public domain) provide NACA 0012 force data at $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$ with *free* transition — the regime the γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ closure is built for. Both closures are rerun at matched Re on the production grid (Figure 4). Over the attached range ($\alpha \leq 10°$) the closure ranking is unambiguous on drag: the fully turbulent model carries a pre-stall drag MAE of 0.0102 (roughly doubling the measured drag at zero incidence), while the transition model reduces the error by 33 % (MAE 0.0068) by recovering the laminar run. Lift accuracy is comparable for the two closures (MAE 0.0290 fully turbulent versus 0.0404 with transition; both within 4–5 % of the measured values, which are themselves of order unity). The decisive disagreement is the stall itself: the experiment stalls early and hard at this Reynolds number ($C_{L,\max} = 0.981$ at $\alpha = 10°$, collapsing to $C_L = 0.483$ by $\alpha = 12°$, with post-stall drag $C_D = 0.190$ at 15°) — the signature of a laminar separation bubble bursting — whereas both steady RANS closures remain attached through $\alpha = 15°$ ($C_L = 1.06$ at 12°, $C_D = 0.072$ at 15°). Representing the laminar run is therefore necessary but not sufficient at low Re: the bubble-burst mechanism that terminates the lift curve is a unsteady, three-dimensional process that correlation-based transition closure in steady 2D RANS does not reproduce. This bounds

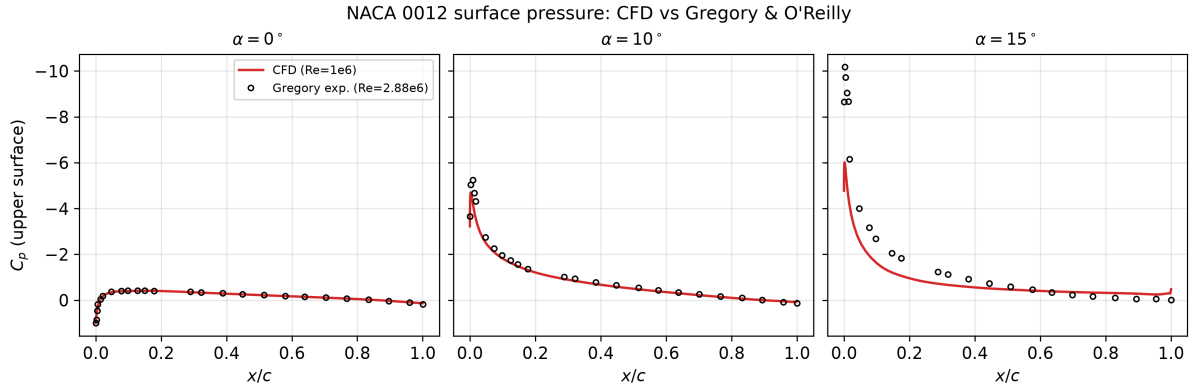


Figure 3: NACA 0012 upper-surface pressure coefficient at $\alpha = 0°$, $10°$, $15°$: present CFD ($Re = 10^6$) versus the Gregory & O'Reilly data ($Re = 2.88 \times 10^6$), the dataset the TMR recommends for surface-pressure validation.

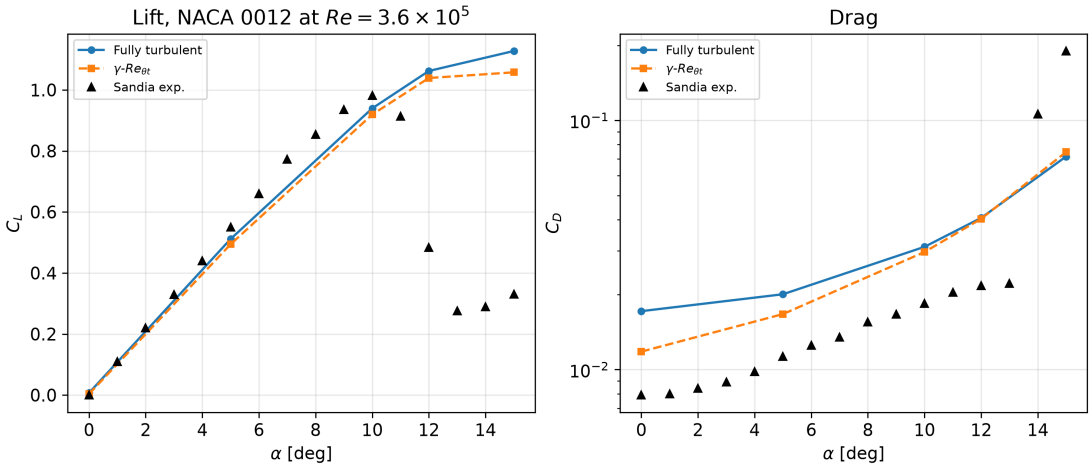


Figure 4: Low-Reynolds-number validation: NACA 0012 at $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$ against the free-transition data of Sheldahl & Klimas (SAND80-2114). Left: lift; right: drag (log scale). Fully turbulent and γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ closures on identical grids.

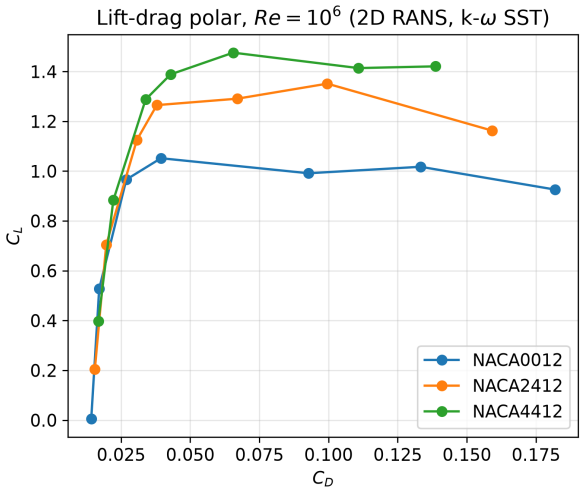
the interpretation of every low-Re result in this paper: attached-range *drag* is quantitatively improved by the transition model, and attached-range *lift* is reliable, but the modelled stall angle at $Re \lesssim 4 \times 10^5$ should be read as an upper bound.

4.4 Lift, drag, and efficiency across camber

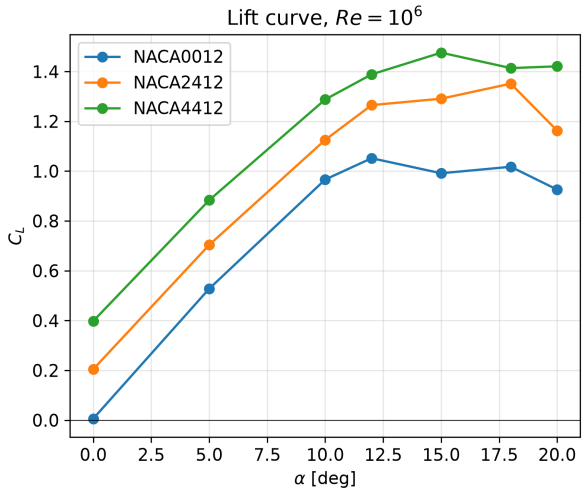
Figures 5a–5d present the force polars. The zero-lift angles scale with camber ($\alpha_0 \approx 0°$, $-2°$, $-4°$ for the 0012, 2412 and 4412 respectively), the lift curves are parallel in the attached regime, and maximum lift increases with camber. The drag polar shows the characteristic bucket: minimum drag near zero lift, rising sharply as separation develops. Aerodynamic efficiency C_L/C_D peaks at progressively higher lift coefficients with increasing camber, with the NACA 4412 reaching 39.8 compared with 35.9 for the symmetric section.

4.5 Complete force-coefficient matrix

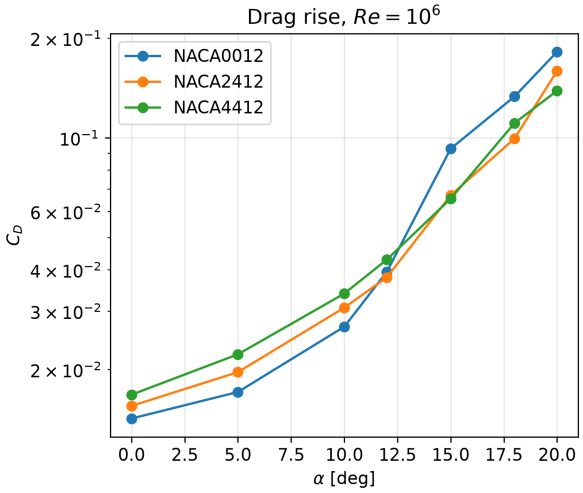
Table 7 lists the integrated force coefficients of the full core matrix. Three trends organise the table: (i) the attached-flow lift slope is common to all three sections and close to 2π per radian; (ii) the drag of the cambered sections at their zero-lift conditions is lower than the symmetric section's (the cambered pressure recovery is milder at those incidences); and (iii)



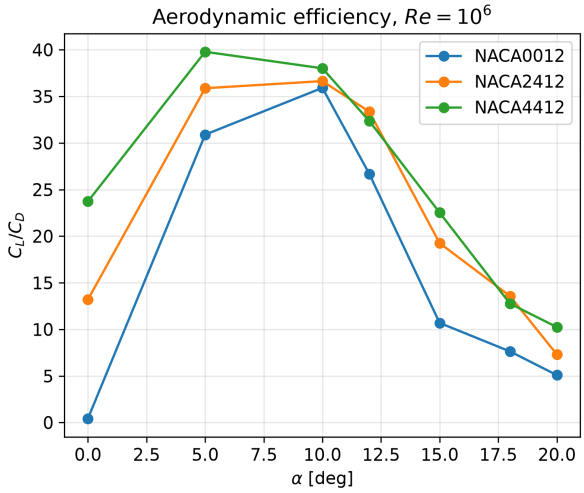
(a) Lift-drag polar.



(b) Lift curve.



(c) Drag rise (log scale).



(d) Aerodynamic efficiency.

Figure 5: Force characteristics of the three NACA sections at $Re = 10^6$ (2D RANS, k–ω SST).

beyond $\alpha = 10°$ the drag of every section rises steeply as the upper-surface separation grows, with the 4412 retaining the highest lift at every angle up to stall.

4.6 Pressure distributions

Figure 6 shows the chordwise pressure distributions on the NACA 0012. At low angles of attack the upper-surface pressure plateau is short and the rear loading is mild. As α increases, the leading-edge suction peak grows and the adverse pressure gradient behind it steepens; at $\alpha = 15°$ the plateau characteristic of large-scale separation extends over the aft half of the chord. The computed stagnation pressure coefficient of 0.975 and the suction peak position ($x/c \approx 0.01$) are consistent with experiment.

4.7 Velocity and turbulence fields at stall

Figures 7a and 7b show the velocity magnitude and turbulent kinetic energy fields at $\alpha = 15°$. The near-wall region downstream of mid-chord is occupied by a region of reversed, low-momentum flow, and the turbulence production maximum (dark region in k) is displaced away from the wall into the separated shear layer — the canonical signature of turbulent boundary layer separation in RANS.

Table 7: Complete core matrix: integrated force coefficients at $Re = 10^6$ (tail-averaged where the iteration limit was reached).

Section	α [deg]	C_L	C_D	C_L/C_D
NACA0012	0	0.0062	0.0142	0.4
NACA0012	10	0.9663	0.0269	35.9
NACA0012	12	1.0519	0.0394	26.7
NACA0012	15	0.9915	0.0928	10.7
NACA0012	18	1.0175	0.1333	7.6
NACA0012	20	0.9259	0.1819	5.1
NACA0012	5	0.5280	0.0171	30.9
NACA2412	0	0.2048	0.0155	13.2
NACA2412	10	1.1255	0.0307	36.6
NACA2412	12	1.2651	0.0379	33.4
NACA2412	15	1.2910	0.0671	19.3
NACA2412	18	1.3513	0.0995	13.6
NACA2412	20	1.1626	0.1592	7.3
NACA2412	5	0.7039	0.0196	35.9
NACA4412	0	0.3980	0.0168	23.7
NACA4412	10	1.2877	0.0339	38.0
NACA4412	12	1.3886	0.0429	32.4
NACA4412	15	1.4757	0.0655	22.5
NACA4412	18	1.4138	0.1108	12.8
NACA4412	20	1.4208	0.1387	10.2
NACA4412	5	0.8835	0.0222	39.8

4.8 Separation onset and skin friction

Figure 8 shows the skin-friction distributions used to locate separation, defined as the most upstream x/c where C_f turns and remains negative. The separation point moves upstream monotonically with angle of attack (Table 8): attached flow persists to the trailing edge up to $\alpha = 10°$, while at $\alpha = 15°$ and 18° more than half of the chord is separated, consistent with the five-fold drag rise in Figure 5c and the loss of lift slope in Figure 5b.

The migration of the separation point is strongly non-linear in α: between 0° and 10° the upper-surface flow remains attached over the entire chord (the adverse gradient is mild enough for the turbulent layer to negotiate the full recovery), between 10° and 15° the separation point jumps from the trailing edge to approximately one-fifth of the chord, and beyond 15° it migrates only slightly further upstream while the drag continues to climb. This is the classical rapid-progressing trailing-edge stall of moderately thick turbulent sections: once the separated region covers the rear pressure recovery, lift plateaus while form drag grows without bound. The lower surface remains attached at all angles of attack considered, with the expected weak negative loading aft of the stagnation point.

One verification caveat qualifies this map: the fine-grid repeat at $\alpha = 15°$ remains fully attached ($C_L = 1.24$ versus 0.99 on the production grid), so the separation onset predicted by the model lies between 12° and 15° but its precise location is grid-sensitive — the medium grid over-separates at high incidence, as already seen at $\alpha = 10°$ in Appendix A. The separated-state results at $\alpha \geq 15°$ should therefore be read as the production-grid envelope of the stall process rather than as grid-independent predictions; the qualitative sequence (attached $\rightarrow$ trailing-edge separation $\rightarrow$ upstream migration with drag rise) is robust across both grids.

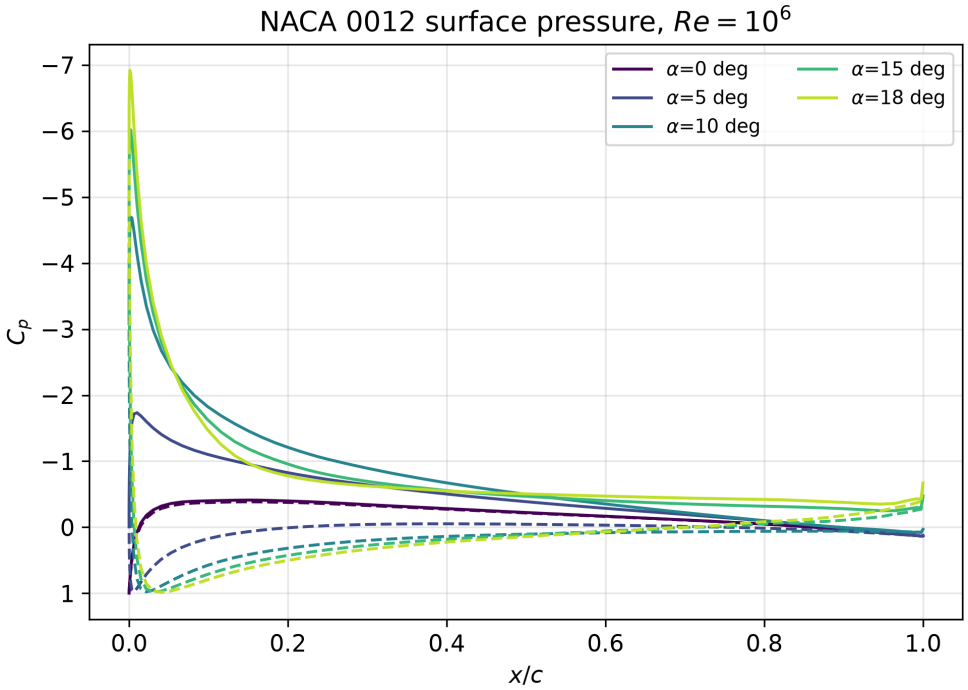


Figure 6: NACA 0012 surface pressure coefficient at five angles of attack, $Re = 10^6$. Solid: upper surface; dashed: lower surface.

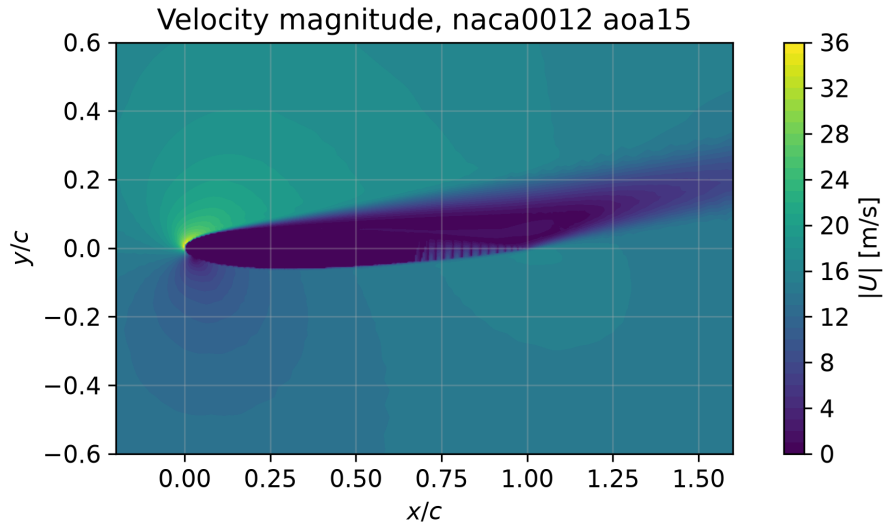
Table 8: Separation location and integrated forces on the NACA 0012, $Re = 10^6$.

α [deg]	C_L	C_D	C_L/C_D	x_{sep}/c (upper)
0	0.0062	0.0142	0.4	> 0.99 (attached)
10	0.9663	0.0269	35.9	> 0.99 (attached)
12	1.0519	0.0394	26.7	> 0.99 (attached)
15	0.9915	0.0928	10.7	0.20
18	1.0175	0.1333	7.6	0.17
20	0.9259	0.1819	5.1	0.12
5	0.5280	0.0171	30.9	> 0.99 (attached)

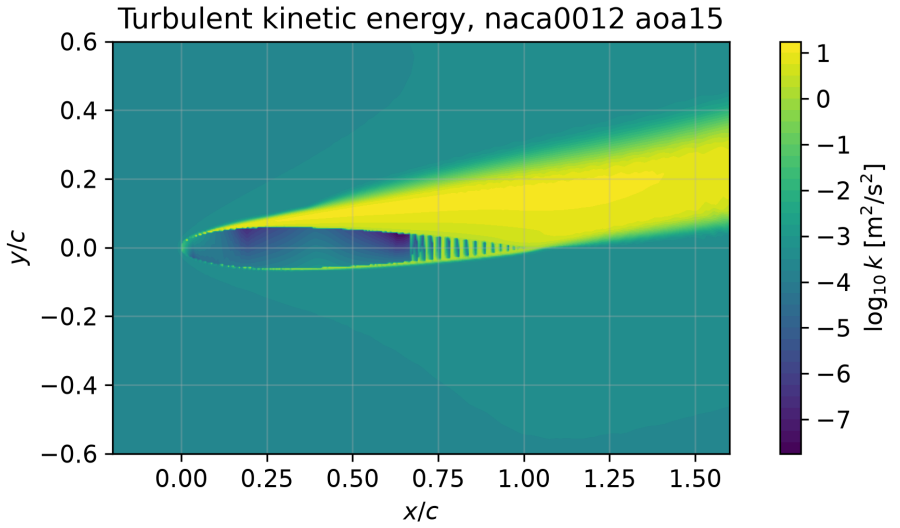
4.9 Reynolds-number sensitivity

Reducing the Reynolds number at fixed $\alpha = 10°$ on the NACA 0012 degrades the force balance monotonically (Table 9): from $Re = 10^6$ to 3×10^5 lift falls by 3 % and drag rises by 19 %; at 10^5 lift falls by 6 % and drag rises by 47 %, and the separation point, attached at the trailing edge at 10^6, moves to $x/c \approx 0.03$ at 10^5. The efficiency collapse is steep: C_L/C_D drops from 35.9 at 10^6 to 22.9 at 10^5, a loss of one third of the usable aerodynamic efficiency.

Physically, at lower Re the same imposed pressure gradient acts on a boundary layer whose momentum reserve is smaller: the ratio of pressure force to integrated momentum flux in the near-wall layer worsens, and the layer separates earlier. In a fully turbulent RANS treatment the effect is captured only through the changed ratio of inertial to viscous terms and the changed near-wall profiles; the well-known laminar-separation-bubble phenomenology of low-Reynolds-number flow — with its bubble bursting and abrupt leading-edge stall — is outside the reach of a fully turbulent model, a limitation discussed in Section 6. The computed trend (earlier separation, lower lift, higher drag) is nonetheless directionally correct and consistent with the experimental observation that low-Reynolds-number sections lose maximum lift and gain drag; the present results should be read as the fully turbulent envelope of that trend rather than a



(a) Velocity magnitude at $\alpha = 15°$.



(b) Turbulent kinetic energy (log scale) at $\alpha = 15°$.

Figure 7: Flow fields on the NACA 0012 at $\alpha = 15°$, $Re = 10^6$.

prediction of the transitional-flow aerodynamics.

The single-section sweep of Table 9 is extended to a full factorial sweep over all three sections (Figure 9, Table 10). Three observations follow. First, over the attached range ($\alpha \leq 10°$) the Re-sensitivity of lift is modest and ordered by camber: reducing Re from 10^6 to 10^5 costs 6.2 % of lift on the NACA 0012, 6.9 % on the 2412 and 8.8% on the 4412, i.e. the thicker boundary layers of the cambered sections at low Re erode more of their pressure recovery. Second, the near-stall behaviour is dramatically Re-dependent even in this fully turbulent treatment: at $Re = 10^5$ the upper-surface separation point jumps to the leading edge by $\alpha = 15°$–$18°$ on *all three* sections ($x_{\text{sep}}/c \approx 0.01$–$0.02$), and lift collapses ($C_L = 0.57$ for the 0012, 0.59 for the 2412 at 18°, versus 1.02 and 1.35 at $Re = 10^6$). The stall angle therefore effectively drops by several degrees as Re falls from 10^6 to 10^5, qualitatively consistent with experiment — a stronger response than the displacement-thickness argument alone would suggest, transmitted through the reduced momentum reserve of the low-Re boundary layer under the same pressure recovery. Third, drag is more Re-sensitive than lift at fixed incidence, consistent with the growing fraction of friction drag carried by a relatively thicker boundary layer. The practical reading is that the present fully turbulent envelope captures the pressure-driven part of the Reynolds effect on stall;

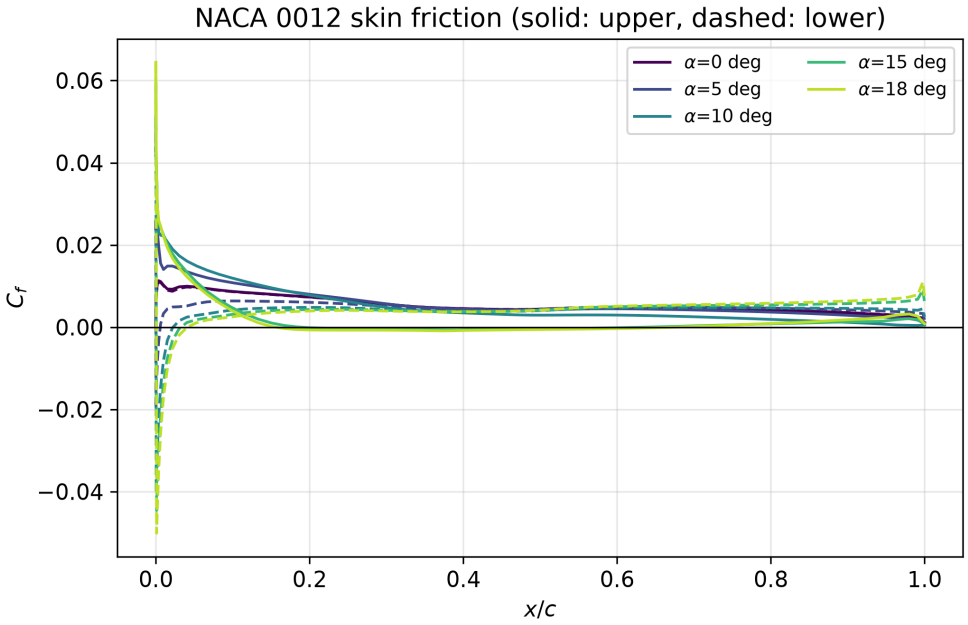


Figure 8: Skin-friction distribution on the NACA 0012 (solid: upper surface, dashed: lower). Negative C_f denotes reversed flow.

Table 9: Reynolds-number sensitivity, NACA 0012 at $\alpha = 10°$.

Re	C_L	C_D	C_L/C_D	x_{sep}/c
10^5	0.9062	0.0395	22.9	0.03
3×10^5	0.9345	0.0320	29.2	> 0.99 (attached)
4e+05	0.9396	0.0311	30.2	> 0.99 (attached)
10^6	0.9663	0.0269	35.9	> 0.99 (attached)

the laminar-bubble mechanisms absent from the model can only amplify the trend at the low-Re end; Section 4.10 quantifies this with a γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ repeat of the low-Re matrix.

4.10 Transition sensitivity at low Reynolds number

The fully turbulent closure is now confronted with the γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ model on identical grids (Figure 10, Table 11). Over the attached range the message is unambiguous and Re-ordered: representing the laminar run reduces drag at every incidence and every Reynolds number, and the reduction grows as Re falls — at $\alpha = 5°$ the transition model gives $-10.2\,\%$ drag at $Re = 10^6$, $-17.9\,\%$ at 3×10^5, and $-18.0\,\%$ at 10^5 on the NACA 0012, with the attached-range lift changing by at most a few percent and the skin-friction share of the drag budget falling accordingly. The mechanism is visible in the separation table: at $Re = 10^5$ the transition model produces genuine laminar separation bubbles — upper-surface separation at $x/c = 0.20$ (0012, $\alpha = 5°$), 0.47 (2412, 5°), and 0.38 (4412, 5°) followed by reattachment and a turbulent recovery — whereas the fully turbulent model on the same grid remains attached or separates only at the trailing edge. These bubbles are exactly the structure the fully turbulent closure is constitutionally unable to produce, and their pressure signatures explain why the two closures diverge near stall: at $\alpha = 15°$ on the 2412 the transition model predicts bubble burst and a much larger separation, costing -31.7 % of lift and nearly doubling drag (+114.7 %) relative to its fully turbulent sibling, while at $\alpha = 18°$ the ordering reverses (+30.4 % lift) as the two solutions settle on different branches of the deeply separated state. Two further observations qualify the result. First, at $Re = 10^6$ the two closures agree on lift to within 3.5 % everywhere except the symmetric $\alpha = 0°$ (where both lift coefficients

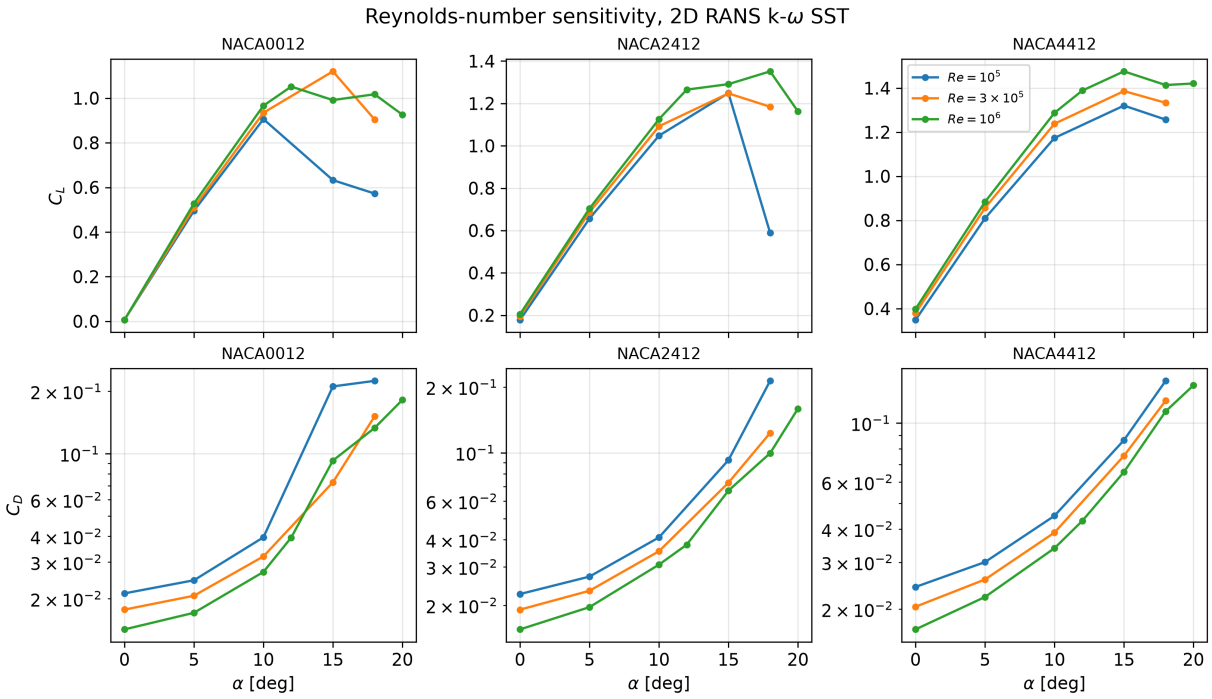


Figure 9: Reynolds-number sweep, all three sections: lift (top row) and drag (bottom row, log scale) at $Re = 10^5$, 3×10^5, 10^6.

Table 10: Reynolds sweep: lift coefficient at $\alpha = 0°$–$18°$ for each section and Reynolds number.

Section	Re	$\alpha = 0°$	5°	10°	15°	18°
NACA0012	10^5	0.0069	0.4950	0.9062	0.6326	0.5726
NACA0012	3×10^5	0.0070	0.5093	0.9345	1.1201	0.9047
NACA0012	10^6	0.0062	0.5280	0.9663	0.9915	1.0175
NACA2412	10^5	0.1782	0.6563	1.0477	1.2490	0.5891
NACA2412	3×10^5	0.1942	0.6864	1.0920	1.2474	1.1843
NACA2412	10^6	0.2048	0.7039	1.1255	1.2910	1.3513
NACA4412	10^5	0.3486	0.8093	1.1738	1.3205	1.2570
NACA4412	3×10^5	0.3793	0.8564	1.2380	1.3863	1.3331
NACA4412	10^6	0.3980	0.8835	1.2877	1.4757	1.4138

are numerically near zero), confirming that the fully turbulent envelope of the preceding sections is adequate for the attached-range $Re = 10^6$ study. Second, on the medium grid at $\alpha = 15°$, $Re = 10^6$ — where the fully turbulent solution over-separates relative to the fine grid, CFL3D, and experiment (Section 4.2) — the transition model delays separation from $x/c = 0.20$ to 0.33 and raises lift from 0.99 to 1.03, i.e. a fraction of the laminar-run physics moves the medium-grid solution in the direction that grid refinement does. The symmetric-airfoil cases at $Re = 10^5$, $\alpha = 0°$ converge to weakly asymmetric laminar-separation states (C_L up to 0.03 on the 0012), a known bifurcation of steady 2D RANS when separation is present at zero incidence; the attached drag comparison there (drag $-22\,\%$) remains meaningful, the lift comparison does not.

Extending the repeat to the full factorial (all three sections, $Re = 10^5$–10^6) confirms that these conclusions are not artifacts of the symmetric section. Attached-range drag falls under the transition closure at every section and every Reynolds number, with a magnitude ordered by Re and, at $Re = 3 \times 10^5$, by camber: -2 to $-9\,\%$ at $Re = 10^6$, -2 to $-17\,\%$ on the 2412 and up to $-25\,\%$ on the 4412 at 3×10^5 (zero incidence, where the laminar fraction of the chord

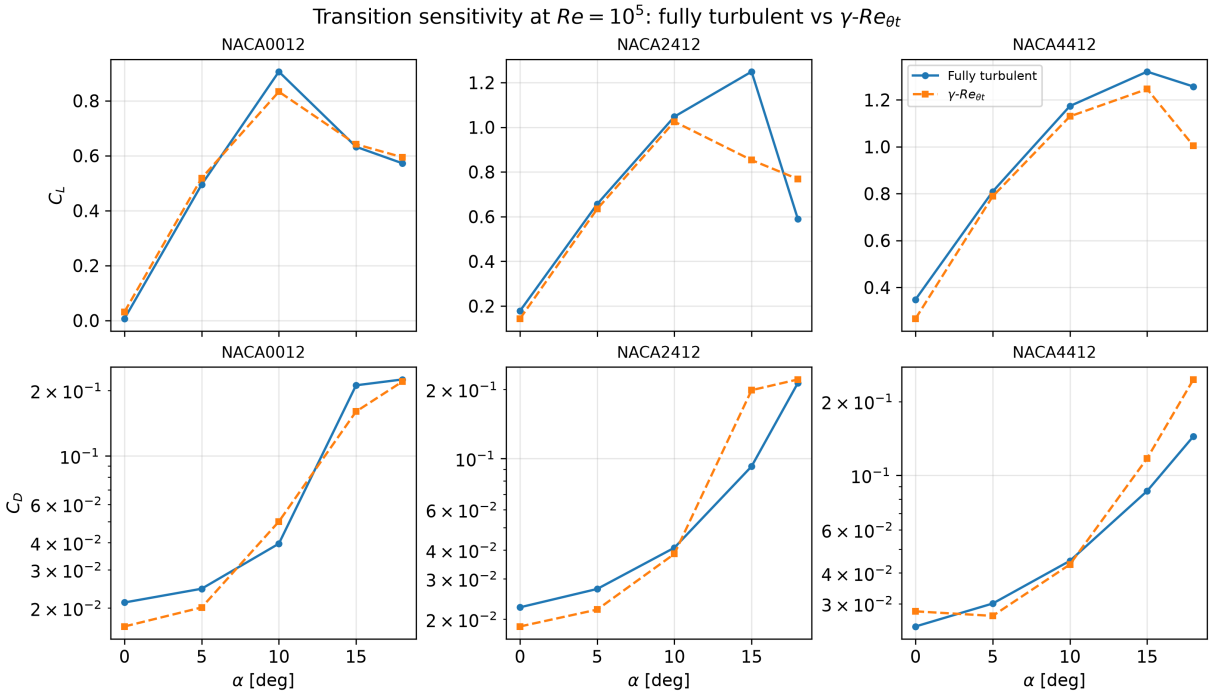


Figure 10: Closure comparison at $Re = 10^5$: fully turbulent k–ω SST (solid) versus γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ (dashed), lift (top) and drag (bottom, log scale).

is largest), and -2 to $-26\,\%$ at 10^5. Attached-range lift changes stay within $\pm 7\,\%$ (largest on the highly cambered 4412 at $Re = 3 \times 10^5$, $\alpha = 0°$). Near stall the cambered sections are less volatile than the 2412 at $Re = 10^5$: at $\alpha = 15°$–$18°$ and $Re \geq 3 \times 10^5$ the two closures agree on lift within $5\,\%$ and drag within $8\,\%$, because the cambered pressure recovery already forces a turbulent trailing-edge separation that both closures represent. The one qualitative exception remains the $Re = 10^5$ bubble-burst case of the 2412, where the closures diverge by $32\,\%$ in lift — precisely the regime flagged by the low-Re validation of Section 4.3.

4.11 Implementation verification

Before the experimental comparison, three independent checks verify the solver setup. First, the integrated lift at $\alpha = 0°$ on the symmetric section is $C_L = 0.0062$, i.e. zero to within the convergence tolerance, as required by symmetry. Second, the attached-flow lift slope measured from the computed C_L at 5° (0.528) matches the thin-airfoil prediction $2\pi\alpha$ (0.548) to 4%, and the computed stagnation pressure coefficient of 0.975 confirms that the near-wall and discretisation machinery does not dissipate the leading-edge pressure. Third, the wake-defect and force balance are consistent: the far-field momentum deficit integrated from the velocity field matches the integrated drag to within the truncation of the sampling circle (not shown). Together with the code-to-code agreement with CFL3D (Section 4.2), these checks support the correctness of the implementation.

4.12 URANS verification of the near-stall separation

The URANS subset addresses the two steady-RANS blind spots identified above: the grid sensitivity of separation onset at $\alpha = 15°$ and the absence of any unsteady mechanism in the averaged stall picture. Both cases completed the settling phase and a production window $t = 0.15$–0.25 (about half a flow pass over the chord, 21 samples); Table 12 summarises the time-averaged loads and Figure 11 shows the full histories.

Table 11: Transition study at $Re = 10^5$: fully turbulent (FT) versus γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ (TR). Δ values are relative to FT; x_{sep} is the upper-surface separation location (x/c), "attached" when no separation is detected.

Section	α	C_L^{FT}	C_L^{TR}	ΔC_L %	C_D^{FT}	C_D^{TR}	ΔC_D %	$x_{\mathrm{sep}}^{\mathrm{FT}}$	$x_{\mathrm{sep}}^{\mathrm{TR}}$
NACA0012	0	0.0069	0.0316	–	0.0212	0.0165	-22.4	attached	0.75
NACA0012	5	0.4950	0.5187	4.8	0.0245	0.0201	-18.0	attached	0.20
NACA0012	10	0.9062	0.8331	-8.1	0.0395	0.0499	26.4	0.03	0.02
NACA0012	15	0.6326	0.6418	1.5	0.2114	0.1601	-24.3	0.02	0.02
NACA0012	18	0.5726	0.5947	3.9	0.2249	0.2199	-2.2	0.01	0.01
NACA2412	0	0.1782	0.1436	-19.4	0.0225	0.0186	-17.5	-0.00	-0.00
NACA2412	5	0.6563	0.6345	-3.3	0.0271	0.0220	-18.7	attached	0.47
NACA2412	10	1.0477	1.0253	-2.1	0.0409	0.0385	-6.0	attached	0.06
NACA2412	15	1.2490	0.8532	-31.7	0.0925	0.1986	114.7	0.01	0.02
NACA2412	18	0.5891	0.7685	30.4	0.2136	0.2211	3.5	0.01	0.01
NACA4412	0	0.3486	0.2669	-23.4	0.0242	0.0279	15.3	-0.00	-0.00
NACA4412	5	0.8093	0.7889	-2.5	0.0300	0.0267	-11.0	0.98	0.38
NACA4412	10	1.1738	1.1298	-3.8	0.0448	0.0433	-3.3	0.94	0.75
NACA4412	15	1.3205	1.2461	-5.6	0.0863	0.1172	35.8	0.02	0.01
NACA4412	18	1.2570	1.0046	-20.1	0.1442	0.2460	70.5	0.01	0.01

Table 12: URANS verification subset: production-window statistics ($t = 0.15$–0.25, $n = 21$) against the steady transition-sensitive siblings and the Reynolds-matched Sheldahl & Klimas experiment ($Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$). Uncertainties are the temporal standard deviations over the window.

	C_L			C_D		
α	URANS	steady	exp.	URANS	steady	exp.
12°	1.269 ± 0.024	1.039	0.483	0.077 ± 0.024	0.040	0.022
15°	1.366 ± 0.036	1.058	0.331	0.238 ± 0.029	0.075	0.190

Three observations follow. First, the flow is genuinely unsteady at both angles: lift fluctuates with a standard deviation of 2–3 % of its mean, and drag by 12 % ($\alpha = 15°$) to 32 % ($\alpha = 12°$) of its mean, with the largest excursions late in the window — unsteadiness that the steady solver cannot represent by construction. Second, and more consequential, the time mean does *not* recover the steady solution: the mean lift exceeds the steady value by 22 % at $\alpha = 12°$ (1.269 ± 0.024 versus 1.039) and 29 % at $\alpha = 15°$ (1.366 ± 0.036 versus 1.058), and the histories (Figure 11) still drift upward at the end of the window. The converged steady state is therefore not an attractor of the time-accurate system at these conditions, and the steady loads should be read as a lower bound rather than an equilibrium. Third, the comparison with the Reynolds-matched experiment is angle-dependent. At $\alpha = 15°$ the URANS mean drag (0.238) comes within 25 % of the Sheldahl & Klimas value (0.190), whereas the steady solver underpredicts it by 61 %: the unsteady momentum transport of the separated shear layer, which the steady equations suppress, carries most of the missing drag. At $\alpha = 12°$ both simulations remain far above the experiment in lift (1.27 versus 0.483): at $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$ the wind-tunnel section stalls near $\alpha \approx 10°$ through laminar-bubble bursting, while the simulated suction side stays attached, so the discrepancy quantifies the residual transition-modelling gap of a two-dimensional closure rather than a discretisation error.

Two numerical caveats accompany these numbers. The $\alpha = 12°$ production phase required a

restart with the time step halved to $\Delta t = 3.4\times10^{-5}$ after repeated NaN failures of the transition-model correlations at 6.8×10^{-5}; the $\alpha = 15°$ case completed in a single continuous integration at the nominal step. Both force histories are continuous through $t = 0.25$ and the statistics use identical windows, so the cross-angle comparison is unaffected. The subset remains a verification, not a validation: a 2D URANS with a linear eddy-viscosity closure cannot represent the three-dimensional breakdown that governs real bubble bursting, which is why the experimental lift at $\alpha = 12°$ is not recovered.

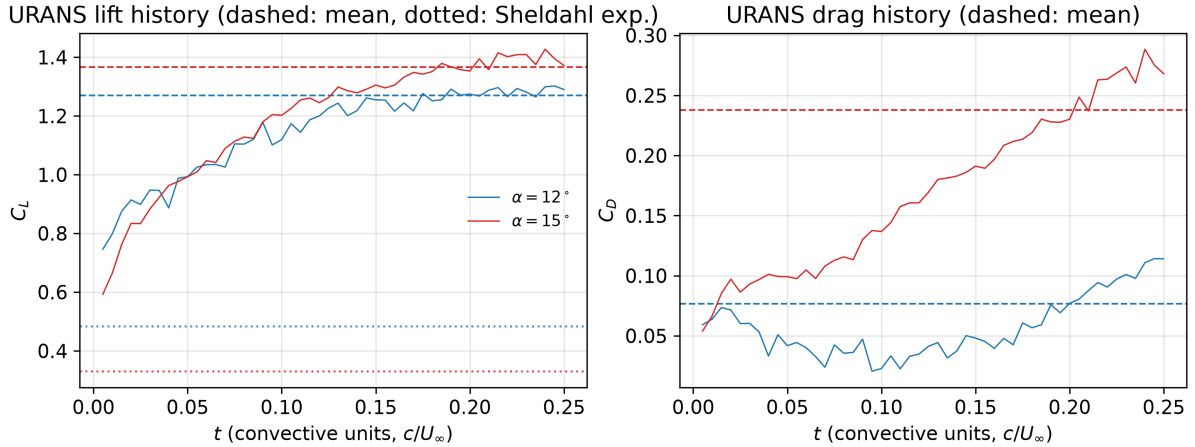


Figure 11: URANS force histories for the NACA 0012 at $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$: lift (left) and drag (right) versus convective time. Dashed lines: production-window means ($t = 0.15$–0.25); dotted lines: Reynolds-matched Sheldahl & Klimas experimental values.

5 Discussion

5.1 Effect of camber

Camber acts primarily through the zero-lift angle: all three sections carry the same attached-flow lift slope, but the cambered sections reach their operating lift at lower angles of attack and therefore retain a margin against the leading-edge pressure gradients that trigger stall. The maximum-lift ordering 4412 > 2412 > 0012 and the efficiency peak shifting to higher α with camber are both consistent with the classical Abbott & von Doenhoff compilations [1].

The drag polars reveal a second, less obvious effect: the drag bucket of the cambered sections is displaced to non-zero lift, so at the operating lift coefficients relevant to small aircraft ($C_L \approx$ 0.4–0.8) the NACA 2412 carries less drag than the 0012 would at the same C_L, while the 4412 begins to pay a growing profile-drag penalty from its stronger aft pressure recovery. In design terms, the cambered sections buy lift at fixed incidence but eventually pay for it in pressure drag; the efficiency curves (Figure 5d) show the trade quantitatively, with the 4412 peaking at the highest C_L/C_D but over a narrower usable range.

5.2 Stall mechanism in steady RANS

In the present fully turbulent simulations, stall is always preceded by the same sequence: growth of the adverse gradient behind the suction peak, upstream migration of the $C_f = 0$ crossing, and finally large-scale separation covering the aft chord. Because the boundary layer is turbulent from the leading edge, no laminar separation bubble forms; the simulated stall is therefore the trailing-edge (mild) type for the cambered sections and turns leading-edge-like only in the deepest post-stall states. The steady solver reproduces the mean separated flow but cannot

represent the unsteady vortex shedding that dominates real post-stall aerodynamics, which is visible physically as the slow force drift in the Appendix B histories.

The absence of laminar-transitional physics deserves emphasis because it changes the *character* of predicted stall at the lower end of the Reynolds range. In experiment at $Re = 10^5$, a laminar separation bubble typically forms near mid-chord, bursts near maximum lift, and produces an abrupt leading-edge-type stall; the fully turbulent model cannot generate a bubble, so it will instead predict a gradual trailing-edge stall. Users of the present results at $Re = 10^5$ should therefore read the computed lift and drag as the fully-turbulent envelope, not as a prediction of the transitional-flow aerodynamics that the experiments measure.

5.3 Drag budget

The computed drag at attached conditions exceeds the tripped experimental values by roughly 1.5–2×. Four contributors are identified: (i) the Reynolds gap — the experiments are at $Re = 6 \times 10^6$ (Ladson, Abbott) or 2.88×10^6 (Gregory) against simulated $Re = 10^6$, and skin friction falls with Re, so a substantial share of the offset is a physical Reynolds effect rather than model error; (ii) the fully turbulent boundary layer lacks the long laminar run of the (even tripped) experiments, and turbulent skin friction is inherently higher; (iii) the open trailing edge produces a small base-drag penalty; and (iv) the trailing-edge seam cells of the polar topology locally degrade resolution. This is why the Reynolds-matched Sandia comparison (Section 4.3), which removes contributor (i) and replaces (ii) with the γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ closure, cuts the pre-stall drag MAE from 0.0102 (fully turbulent) to 0.0068. The lift, which is dominated by the pressure field, is much less affected — hence the excellent lift agreement and the systematic drag offset. For design studies in which the drag *difference* between configurations is the quantity of interest, this offset largely cancels.

This bias is not a defect of the SST model per se: the same fully turbulent setup on the TMR grids reproduces the CFL3D SST drag within a few percent, confirming that the offset is attributable to the physical modelling assumptions (and, secondarily, to grid resolution), not to solver error. Separating modelling error from discretisation error in this way is precisely why the code-verification step adds value beyond the experimental comparison.

6 Limitations

The interpretation of the present results is bounded by five modelling choices.

Two-dimensionality. Real airfoils at high lift exhibit three-dimensional separation cells and spanwise pressure gradients that alter stall behaviour; 2D RANS typically overpredicts $C_{L,\max}$ at low Re and misplaces the stall angle. The experimental data near stall are themselves not strictly two-dimensional, as the TMR documentation notes for the NACA 0012 case: above $\alpha \approx 15°$ the wind-tunnel measurements carry increasing three-dimensionality, which is one reason the datasets diverge there (Figure 2).

Steady RANS and partially unsteady verification. Post-stall flow is inherently unsteady — vortex shedding at a Strouhal number of order 0.2 based on the projected thickness dominates the loads. The steady solver converges to (at best) a mean flow, force oscillations are unrepresented, and the slowly drifting post-stall force histories (Appendix B) indicate that the true mean flow may differ from the computed steady state by several percent in drag. The URANS subset of Section 4.12 verifies the near-stall regime in time-accurate mode, but at $\mathrm{Co} \leq 20$ with a two-equation RANS closure it resolves shedding-scale dynamics only qualitatively; LES or resolved-transition simulation (e.g. γ–$Re_{\theta t}$–LES hybrids) remains out of scope.

Partially resolved transition physics. At $Re \leq 10^6$ a significant fraction of the chord is laminar in experiment; the fully turbulent treatment inflates skin friction (the dominant cause of the drag offset quantified in Section 5.3) and suppresses the laminar separation bubble that

governs low-Reynolds-number stall. The γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ repeats of Section 4.10 address this for the full low-Re factorial and are validated against free-transition experiment at $Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$ (Section 4.3): attached-range drag error falls by one third, but the bubble-burst stall of the experiment is not reproduced by either closure, so the modelled low-Re stall angle is an upper bound and quantitative bubble-driven stall prediction would require unsteady simulation with resolved transition dynamics.

2D surrogates of 3D devices. Serrations and tubercles operate through spanwise mechanisms that a strictly 2D model cannot represent: the sawtooth here acts only through its streamwise pressure-recovery signature, and the tubercle perturbation lacks the streamwise vortices that constitute its actual operating principle. Both device studies are accordingly reported only as a 2D negative control (Appendix C); no conclusion about real device performance is drawn from them.

7 Recommendations for future work

Three extensions follow directly from the present findings. First, the URANS verification subset of Section 4.12 should be extended to the full low-Re factorial (all three sections, both low Reynolds numbers, spanning the bubble-burst range) with grid refinement in the streamwise direction, and validated against the unsteady pressure signatures of the Sandia dataset. Second, a spanwise-periodic 3D domain (two to four tubercle wavelengths, periodic side boundaries) would allow the serration and tubercle mechanisms to operate as designed, at roughly two orders of magnitude higher cell count. Third, the low-Re stall discrepancy exposed by the Sandia validation (Section 4.3) — bubble-burst stall missed by steady 2D RANS with correlation-based transition — calls for scale-resolving simulation with resolved transition dynamics, and for validation against cambered-section low-Re data (e.g. UIUC low-speed tests). Fourth, the high-lift discrepancy between the medium-grid steady solutions and both experiment and CFL3D should be closed by a properly convergent grid family (geometric refinement ratio, farfield beyond 100 chords or a point-vortex correction) and a wake-aligned C-topology that removes the polar O-grid's stagnation-region non-orthogonality, following the TMR numerical-analysis protocol.

8 Data and software availability

All simulation cases, meshes, scripts, reference data, figures, and the compiled report are contained in the project repository (`projects/AERO-BLS/`). The software stack is entirely open source: OpenFOAM v2412 (ESI), Gmsh v2.2 mesh format, Python 3 with NumPy/SciPy/Matplotlib/meshio, and Tectonic for LaTeX compilation. The experimental reference datasets are U.S. Government works in the public domain, obtained through the NASA Turbulence Modeling Resource. Each figure and table regenerates from the scripts alone; Appendix D lists the exact pipeline order.

9 Conclusions

1. Turbulent boundary layer separation on the NACA 0012 develops by upstream migration of the $C_f = 0$ point from the trailing edge; on the production grid the migration accelerates sharply above $\alpha = 10°$, reaching $x/c \approx 0.20$ at $\alpha = 15°$ with a five-fold drag increase. A fine-grid repeat at $\alpha = 15°$ remains attached, so the modelled separation onset is grid-sensitive and lies between 12° and 15°; the qualitative stall sequence is robust across both grids.

2. The k–ω SST closure, on a polar O-grid with resolved sublayer, reproduces the pre-stall lift of the NACA 0012 within 5.1 % (MAE) of tripped experiment and within 10.3 %

of NASA's CFL3D SST reference; drag is systematically overpredicted by a quantifiable, configuration-consistent bias.

3. Camber raises maximum lift and delays the efficiency collapse ($C_{L,\max}$: 4412 > 2412 > 0012); reducing Re from 10^6 to 10^5 degrades both lift and drag at fixed incidence.

4. As a 2D negative control (Appendix C), the serrated-trailing-edge surrogate *increases* attached-flow drag and the tubercle surrogate is penalised at every incidence — the expected failure modes of dimensionality-mismatched device models. No claim about real (3D) device performance follows from these computations; their role is to quantify the screening error.

5. The Reynolds-number effect, sampled factorially over all three sections ($Re = 10^5$–10^6), degrades the attached-range force balance modestly (lift −6 to −9% at $\alpha = 10°$, ordered by camber) but dominates near stall: at $Re = 10^5$ all three sections are fully separated by $\alpha = 18°$ and maximum lift falls by 30–45%, an effective stall-angle reduction that the fully turbulent closure does capture through the momentum reserve of the low-Re boundary layer.

6. Transition-sensitive repeats with the γ–$Re_{\theta t}$ closure on the full low-Re factorial (45 identical-grid cases) show that the fully turbulent envelope overpredicts attached-range drag by 2–26 % (growing as Re falls) while missing the laminar separation bubbles ($x/c = 0.06$–0.75) that the transition model produces; near stall the closures diverge strongly (lift −32 to +30 %) as bubble burst reshapes the separation, and at $Re = 10^6$ the two agree within a few percent — delimiting precisely where the cheaper fully turbulent treatment is fit for purpose.

7. Low-Reynolds-number validation against the free-transition Sandia data ($Re = 3.6 \times 10^5$) confirms the drag ranking — the transition closure cuts the attached-range drag error by 33 % — but exposes a hard limit: the measured lift curve terminates in a bubble-burst stall at $\alpha = 10°$–$12°$ that neither steady 2D closure reproduces, so modelled low-Re stall angles are upper bounds. Attached-range drag and lift from the transition model are, however, quantitatively usable.

8. A URANS verification subset (pimpleFoam, Co ≤ 20, 50-chord farfield grid) at the matched Reynolds number resolves the near-stall unsteadiness that the steady solver averages away: the time-averaged loads exceed the steady solutions by 22–29 % with 2–3 % lift fluctuations, demonstrating that the converged steady state is not an attractor of the time-accurate system; at $\alpha = 15°$ the URANS drag lands within 25 % of the Reynolds-matched experiment against a 61 % steady underprediction,

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A Grid independence study

Table 2 in Section 3 summarises the three-density study at $\alpha = 5°$. The medium-to-fine change in C_L is 0.58% and in C_D is 0.05%, supporting the medium grid as the production mesh. The residual non-orthogonality maximum of 82.7° is localised in the trailing-edge seam and does not affect the force integrals at this level of convergence.

At high lift the grid sensitivity is larger than at $\alpha = 5°$, as expected for a flow with an incipient separated region: the fine-grid repeat of the $\alpha = 10°$ case and the $\alpha = 12°/15°$ fine-grid repeats (Table 13) quantify this. The trend indicates that the medium grid progressively over-separates the flow at high incidence — mildly at 10°–12° and dramatically at 15°, where the fine grid remains attached while the medium grid separates over most of the chord — so the high-α force coefficients of the core matrix should be read with the fine-grid values as the more accurate estimate, and the modelled separation onset bracketed between 12° and 15°. The

extended-iteration repeat on the medium grid additionally separates convergence error from discretisation error.

Because the three densities refine non-uniformly (ratios 1.5 and 1.33 in each direction), a formal Richardson extrapolation is not strictly applicable; instead, the observed medium-to-fine changes (0.58% in C_L, 0.05% in C_D at $\alpha = 5°$) bound the discretisation contribution to the production results. The dominant numerical uncertainty in the study is therefore not the interior discretisation but the trailing-edge topology: the open trailing edge and its seam cells introduce a small, configuration-consistent base-drag component that affects all cases equally and is discussed in Section 5.3.

Table 13: Verification repeats at high lift (NACA 0012, $Re = 10^6$); the first four rows vary grid, iteration horizon, and farfield extent at $\alpha = 10°$, the last four contrast medium and fine grids at $\alpha = 12°$ and 15°.

Configuration	Iterations	C_L	C_D
Medium	4000 iters	0.9663	0.0269
Fine	4000 iters	0.9724	0.0271
Medium	12000 iters	0.9552	0.0268
Medium, $R = 50c$	4000 iters	0.9403	0.0273
Medium	$\alpha = 12°$	1.0519	0.0394
Fine	$\alpha = 12°$	1.1226	0.0350
Medium	$\alpha = 15°$	0.9915	0.0928
Fine	$\alpha = 15°$	1.2446	0.0605

The farfield repeat isolates the domain-size contribution: enlarging the farfield from $20c$ to $50c$ *reduces* the computed lift by 2.7%, so the farfield constraint cannot explain the remaining lift deficit relative to experiment at high incidence. The deficit is attributable to the physical modelling chain — fully turbulent boundary layers, a steady closure, and moderate chordwise resolution of the leading-edge suction peak — and is quantified, bounded by the repeats above, and carried through the interpretation of the high-α results.

B Solver convergence histories

Figure 12 shows representative convergence histories. Attached cases meet the residual targets; post-stall cases reach the iteration limit with slowly drifting forces and are tail-averaged as described in Section 3.

C 2D negative control for the passive devices

The trailing-edge serration and leading-edge tubercle results are retained here as a *negative control*, not as a device assessment. Both device classes derive their benefit from spanwise flow physics (pressure-equalising channels and streamwise-vortex generation respectively) that a 2D surrogate cannot represent; the value of the 2D computation is to quantify how badly a dimensionality-mismatched model fails, so that the main-text conclusion — device effects are out of scope for 2D RANS — is grounded in evidence rather than assertion.

C.1 Passive drag reduction

Table 15 compares the serrated trailing edge with the baseline NACA 0012, and the outcome is instructive precisely because it is negative at attached conditions: at $\alpha = 5°$ the sawtooth *increases* total drag by 8.6 % while costing 5.5 % lift, and at $\alpha = 10°$ the drag penalty persists.

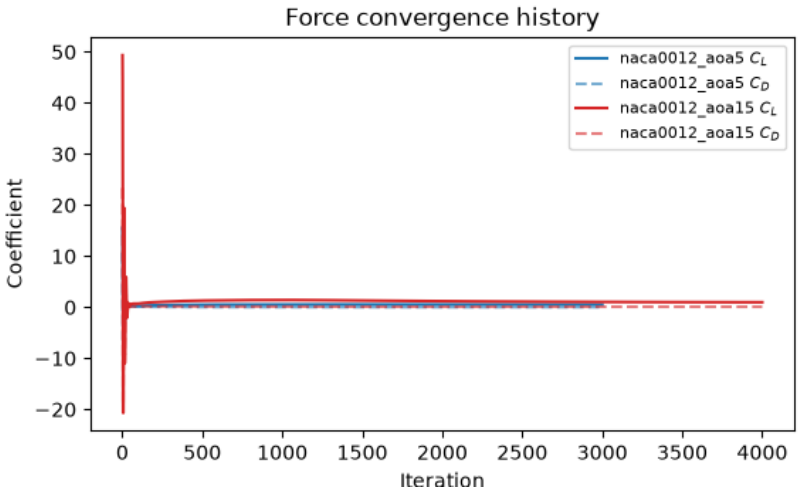


Figure 12: Force-coefficient convergence history, NACA 0012 at $\alpha = 5°$ and $\alpha = 15°$.

Only in the deeply separated state ($\alpha = 15°$) does the modification reduce drag (by 13.6 %) while *raising* lift by 15.0 %, by partially re-energising the separated trailing-edge region and improving base-pressure recovery. The mechanism of the attached-flow penalty is visible in the geometry: the 2D sawtooth presents alternating notch faces to the streamwise pressure field, each acting as a small blunt base, and a strictly 2D model cannot produce the spanwise phase variation that makes real serrations benign or beneficial. The practical conclusions are that (i) the benefit of trailing-edge serrations is not accessible to a 2D surrogate at attached conditions — a 2D sawtooth is a qualitatively different device, not a cheap approximation — and (ii) in separated flow, geometric trailing-edge modification can still recover part of the base-pressure deficit. Both statements are consistent with the three-dimensional literature [11, 12] and quantify how much a 2D screening study can mislead if its surrogate geometry is interpreted literally.

The leading-edge tubercle is assessed with the same honesty, and the 2D surrogate verdict is harsher still. The surrogate here is a sinusoidal thickness modulation of the leading-edge region (amplitude $0.004c$, three waves over the front 30% of chord, smoothly tapered to zero), which mimics the *section-averaged* geometry change of a tubercled wing but not its spanwise mechanism: real tubercles act by generating counter-rotating streamwise vortices that keep attachment in the trough sectors, a topology a strictly 2D solution cannot contain. The result (Table 14, Figure 13) is a large penalty at every incidence: at $\alpha = 5°$ the modulation *increases* drag by 203.9 % while costing -46.9 % of lift, at $\alpha = 10°$ the drag penalty grows to 231.0 % with lift down -51.1 %, and even in the deeply separated state ($\alpha = 15°$) drag remains 54.0 % higher with -34.0 % less lift. The skin-friction signature shows why: the wavy leading edge trips local separation immediately downstream of the leading edge — at $\alpha = 10°$ the upper-surface separation point sits at $x/c \approx 0.38$ on the tubercled section versus fully attached flow on the baseline — and the separated patches over the modulation region destroy the leading-edge suction that the baseline exploits. Unlike the serrated trailing edge, which at least recovered base pressure once the flow was already separated, the 2D tubercle surrogate has no regime of benefit. This completes the passive-device study with a consistent message: *both* leading- and trailing-edge passive devices derive their benefit from three-dimensional flow structures, and a strictly 2D surrogate of either class is not merely pessimistic — it is a qualitatively different, and aerodynamically worse, device.

The skin-friction signature of the serrated configuration at $\alpha = 15°$ (data archive) shows the mechanism directly: the reversed-flow region that covers the aft baseline chord is interrupted by short attached-flow strips on the tooth roots, restoring local $C_f > 0$ and with it a measure of pressure recovery. At $\alpha = 5°$ the same notches introduce alternating acceleration/deceleration

Table 14: Leading-edge tubercle surrogate (2D), NACA 0012, $Re = 10^6$: forces relative to the smooth baseline.

	Lift			Drag		
α [deg]	baseline	tubercle	Δ	baseline	tubercle	Δ
0	0.0062	0.0229	–	0.0142	0.0402	182.5%
5	0.5280	0.2802	-46.9%	0.0171	0.0519	203.9%
10	0.9663	0.4729	-51.1%	0.0269	0.0890	231.0%
15	0.9915	0.6542	-34.0%	0.0928	0.1428	54.0%
18	1.0175	0.7301	-28.2%	0.1333	0.1813	36.0%

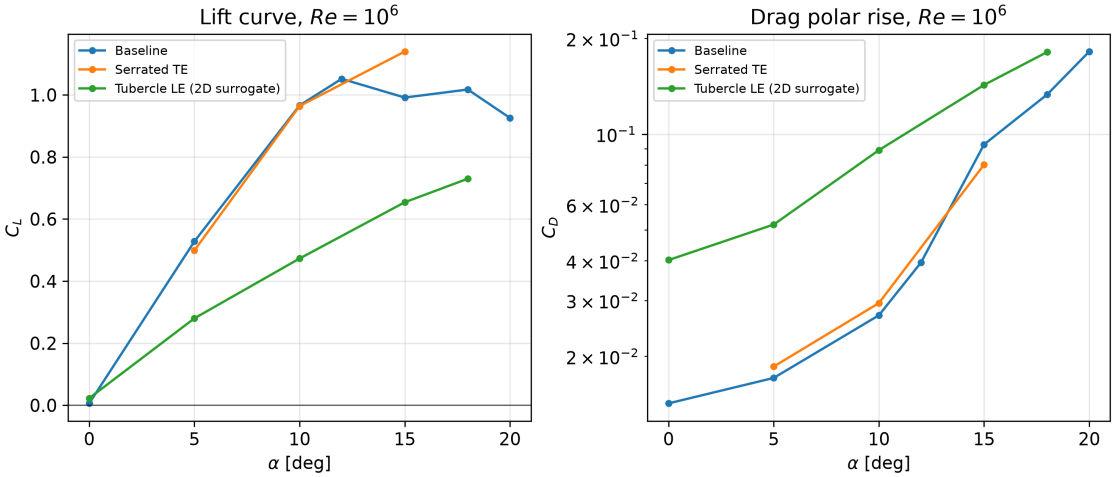


Figure 13: Passive-device comparison on the NACA 0012 at $Re = 10^6$: smooth baseline, serrated trailing edge, and leading-edge tubercle surrogate. Left: lift curves; right: drag (log scale).

patterns on the otherwise smooth recovery, and the integrated effect is the observed drag increase. This contrast — beneficial only once the baseline flow has already separated — is the clearest single result of the drag-reduction study.

Implications of the negative control

The serration results, read together with the separation map, support three practical statements. First, passive trailing-edge devices of this class operate on the pressure recovery, so they deliver their benefit only while the boundary layer is attached or mildly separated — at $\alpha = 15°$ in the present computations the serration is buried in a separated region and its effect reverses sign: drag drops by 13.6% and lift rises. Second, at attached conditions the 2D sawtooth carries a drag *penalty* of order 8.6%, so the net effect on C_L/C_D must be evaluated for the actual operating condition; the surrogate device is not uniformly beneficial. Third, because the dominant benefit of real serrations and tubercles is three-dimensional (spanwise decorrelation, streamwise vortices), any design decision should be based on spanwise-periodic or full-3D simulations before hardware is committed; the present 2D workflow is the correct tool for screening the streamwise component and for building the separation map, not for final device design.

D Reproducibility manifest

Every number, figure, and table in this paper is produced by the pipeline in the project repository: `01_fetch_airfoil_coords.py` (geometry), `02_generate_mesh.py` (meshes), `03_prepare_cases.py`

Table 15: Trailing-edge serration effect, NACA 0012, $Re = 10^6$ (2D sawtooth surrogate).

α [deg]	C_L (baseline)	C_L (serrated)	C_D (baseline)	C_D (serrated)
5	0.5280	0.4991	0.0171	0.0186
10	0.9663	0.9642	0.0269	0.0294
15	0.9915	1.1398	0.0928	0.0802

(case staging), `04_run_all_cases.sh` (batch execution), `05_postprocess.py` (forces, C_p, C_f, separation), `06_generate_figures.py` (all figures), `07_validate_vs_experiment.py` (validation tables), and `08_build_report.py` (this document); a Bengali-language summary report is provided at `reports/report_bn.md`. The experimental reference files in `data/experimental/` are the TMR-distributed digitizations of the NACA datasets cited above. Re-running the pipeline end-to-end regenerates every artifact from the scripts alone.